

Who's in Charge?

Government Type and Coalition Command Structure

Grace Tanner

University of Kentucky

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Abstract

This project explores the relationship between coalition members' government types and their choice of command structure. The central question guiding this inquiry is whether coalition members' regime types influence the decision-making process regarding the structure of the coalition's command. This project examines the impact of the similarity of members' governments' regime types and the power distribution among coalition members on the coalition's choice of command structure.

Keywords: Coalition Warfare, Military Command, Command Structures, Command

Coalition warfare is by no means a modern concept. The idea of states joining their military forces to form a coalition dates back to ancient times. The effectiveness of coalitions has long been a topic of debate between military leaders and scholars. Military leaders have a long-held disdain for coalition warfare due to the increased levels of coordination and planning required for military operations that come along with it. While it has difficulties, Coalition warfare is an effective strategy, and coalitions have a higher chance of victory than fighting alone (Morey 2016). The success of a coalition is largely based on the effectiveness of its command structure. Different types of command structures are based on their level of centralization. Research has shown that higher levels of centralization within a coalition's command structure increase its chances of victory (Morey 2020). Most existing research into coalitions investigates what factors contribute to a coalition's success. However, there is a lack of research into what factors play a role in a coalition's choice of command structure, despite evidence that command structures impact success. This is especially interesting given that coalitions still choose to implement less centralized command structures, despite knowing it could harm their performance. This paper builds on the existing literature and looks at two potential factors that may impact a coalition's choice of command structure: the similarity of regimes and power distribution between coalition members.

Background

Coalitions

Coalitions are formed by states facing a common threat or situation to appease the threat (Morey 2016, Bowman 1997). Morey (2016, 535) defines a coalition as “a group of states that coordinate military activities during a war regardless of the nature of the pre-war relationship.” Coalitions are a type of multilateral security cooperation, like alliances. However, alliances differ from coalitions as alliances can have broader purposes and do not always require military actions. In contrast, a coalition's main objective is defeating the shared enemy via active military coordination (Morey 2016). Coalitions can provide advantages to their member states that are not available to states fighting independently. The main advantage of joining a coalition is that members can combine their military strength to aggregate power. Smaller states that cannot build large armies may be forced to join a coalition when fighting bigger militaries. Joining a coalition may also enable members to specialize in conducting operations that best suit their

military. In many cases, coalition members will grant their fellow members access to their strategic territory. Fighting in a coalition can also force enemies to divide their military forces (Morey 2016).

Joining a coalition can also legitimize a state's objectives by signaling that its actions have broad support. Legitimacy can be both domestic, improving the attitudes of the public and political opponents, or international, regarding other states' attitudes, as the broad showing of support can discourage dissenters from expressing their opinions for fear of negative repercussions. An increase in legitimacy does not improve the coalition's odds of victory. However, it could potentially improve leaders' or states' reputations (Cranmer and Menninga 2018).

Coalitions are not without their problems. Coalitions must overcome a multitude of points of friction to operate successfully. Divergent political goals are one of the more prominent friction points amongst coalition members. While members share the goal of defeating their shared enemy, there is no guarantee that each member will prioritize that goal and not pursue other side quests, which can divert effort from the coalition's primary goal. Members also face varying domestic political situations, and leaders must be concerned with maintaining their power, which can detract from the coalition's goals (Morey 2016). Coalition partners also have differing logistical administrations and doctrines, which they must integrate while considering logistics from a coalition perspective, not just a national one. The individual militaries within a coalition also have different capabilities, and coalition leadership must ensure that responsibilities are divided equally among the members. Leadership must also account for the differing levels and quality of training, potential language barriers, differing qualities and quantities of equipment, and the interoperability of the equipment (Bowman 1997). There are also a variety of differing cultural factors that can create points of friction among members, such as religion, gender roles, class distinctions, work ethic, standards of living, and national traditions (Bowman 1997).

Command Structures

In addition to accounting for all the previous factors, coalitions must address the major command issue. Command is one of the most significant issues that coalitions must overcome to operate effectively. Studies that explore coalitions generally assume that coalitions have

effective, established command structures; however, getting to that point can be extremely difficult. Military command is divided into two parts: operational and strategic control. Strategic control refers to the ability to set overall unit objectives. In a coalition, strategic control is held by the members of the coalition, who negotiate and establish a coalition's overall objectives and goals, and how larger coalition elements are employed. Joining a coalition does not mean a state must give up strategic control. Operational control is determining the tactics and strategies used to achieve an objective. When the term command refers to coalitions, it relates to operational control. Coalitions establish command structures to delegate operational authority, as coalition command is primarily concerned with operational-level command (Morey 2020).

When establishing a command structure, the primary objective of coalitions is to achieve unity of effort. This concept involves all parts of the force working towards the same overall objective, which is crucial in coalition warfare. Unity of effort does not imply that all units are pursuing the same objectives simultaneously; instead, it refers to the division of tasks to individual units and coordinating operations to achieve the most significant effect (Morey 2020). Three distinct styles of command structures or command modes exist: Independent, Joint, and Unified.

Independent or Parallel commands are the least centralized command structures. Under a parallel command structure, coalition partners form a joint battle plan; however, the individual members can execute the strategy independently. Members are frequently assigned a geographical region within which to operate. Integration and coordination are minimal, and operational authority is often given to national command structures to execute the plan in their specific zone. Joint commands are more centralized than Parallel commands but are not as centralized as Unified Commands. Joint Command consists of a single command authority at the top of the hierarchy of command. The command authority comprises a council of commanders from the coalition members who make the operational decisions. The final type of command is a Unified or Lead Nation Command. This is the most centralized command, as coalition members surrender operational control in some capacity to a single individual. One of the pitfalls of implementing a more centralized command structure is requiring more deliberation. In the case of Joint command structures, the committee must deliberate to form a consensus regarding orders, which can slow down a coalition's reaction times. In the case of a unified command structure, members must deliberate upfront about who to elect as commander, which can delay

the initial start of operations, but benefits the coalition during operations, as the decisions are left to the commander's discretion, and do not require the deliberation required in a joint command. Coalitions that implement a stronger, more centralized command structure have been shown to have a higher chance of victory in war. A stronger command structure leads to unity of effort and can mitigate some issues plaguing coalitions (Morey 2020).

Democracies vs. Autocracies in Coalitions

Democracies and Autocracies behave differently in war and coalitions, which play a role in how other states choose their allies and with whom they form coalitions. One of the key concerns of states when determining which other states to collaborate with is the likelihood that the other state will abandon them. States want to ensure their allies follow through on the initial engagement and support the coalition throughout its war efforts. Gartzke and Skrede (2004) found that Democracies were 2.5 times more likely to violate alliance agreements that entail military intervention than autocracies, which they attribute to democratic cycling. Democratic cycling is the constant turnover in leadership in democracies compared to autocracies, since democratic leaders are elected officials. This turnover leads to democratic leaders more frequently institutionalizing alliances to attempt to counteract cycling, as institutionalizing alliances makes it much harder to back out of them. However, these commitments are made with the promise of future intervention, and if there is new leadership elected in between the time the commitment is made and when it is acted upon, who is deeply opposed to these commitments, they may choose not to honor the agreement. If democracies do decide to intervene, Choi (2012) shows that they are less likely to abandon their coalition partners and will fight harder in wars due to the increased domestic political reprisal faced by democratic leaders if they choose to back down and the increased number of veto players involved in the decision-making process making it more difficult to change the status quo. The increased number of veto players in democracies makes them less vulnerable to drastic policy changes than autocracies (Choi 2012).

Democratic states are more attractive allies when forming a coalition. This is because democracies can delegate more responsibility to military leaders, and they have a much lower risk of the military staging a coup than autocratic leaders. Interventions by democratic coalitions are also more likely to be successful than nondemocratic ones, and democracies are more likely to provide higher-quality troops to a coalition (Pilster 2011). Democracies tend to fight in larger

coalitions as their goals incentivize maximizing coalition size and capabilities. Autocracies are disincentivized to increase the number of members in a coalition because their aims more frequently revolve around obtaining private goods, and a greater number of members means splitting the spoils of war more ways. Democracies, on the other hand, tend to pursue public goods, which can be shared among coalition members without diluting anyone's payoff (Graham, et al. 2017).

Democracies are often seen as more attractive partners because of the concept of democratic victory. Democratic victory is the tendency of democracies to win wars, as they win almost all the wars they initiate and two-thirds of the wars where they are the target. However, this effect is not directly tied to regime type. Democracies tend to fight in coalitions with a larger number of members. A higher number of coalition partners increases the likelihood of victory, independent of regime type, meaning democracies tend to win wars because they tend to be part of larger coalitions, not because they are democracies. This means that fighting with more partners increases the probability of victory for autocracies and democracies, and the size of the coalition has a more significant impact than regime type on a coalition's likelihood of victory. More powerful coalitions also have higher probabilities of victory, meaning coalitions are incentivized to include as many powerful members as possible to increase their capabilities (Graham, et al. 2017).

Theory

Joining a coalition is preferable to fighting alone, but for the benefits of coalition warfare to be realized, a coalition must have an adequate command structure (Morey 2016). When coalitions form their command structure, they aim to choose one with the highest probability of success, but it also must adequately address any issues with coordination and cooperation that may arise. Higher levels of centralization generally have higher probabilities of success, as a weak command structure can result in an inefficient aggregation of members' military capabilities (Morey 2020). However, higher levels of centralization require more diligent cooperation and coordination. If those issues cannot be addressed, or if the command structure creates new problems that cannot be overcome, the coalition is largely rendered ineffective. The benefits of coalition warfare are no longer realized, as the literature on the benefits of coalitions assumes that the coalition has an effective command structure (Morey 2020). In instances where

having a more centralized command structure would create more issues that the command structure cannot address, the coalition members face the decision to either stay with the existing command structure, but face insurmountable coordination issues, or dissolve the coalition and fight alone, or opt for a lower level of centralization within their command that does not create as severe of coordination issues. For more powerful states with the military capabilities to fight a conflict alone, the best option may be to fight alone. The much smaller states that do not have the capabilities to wage war on their own either must devise a way to overcome the coordination issues and make the coalition work or face defeat. Essentially, a command structure cannot create more problems than it is able to solve. If it does, the members must adapt the command structure so that it accounts for these issues or face a much lower probability of victory. Several different factors could contribute to the formation of these issues. The rest of this paper examines how coalition members' government types and the power distribution of the coalition impact the coalition's choice of command structure.

Regime Type Similarity

Democracies and Autocracies behave very differently in coalitions, which could make coordination between the two much more difficult. Democracies delegate more responsibility to military commanders than autocracies, which could create problems in a unified or parallel command (Pilster 2011). Autocratic commanders may not have the same abilities or power as democratic commanders and, therefore, cannot do what is asked of them. Democracies and autocracies also often have different aims from each other, as autocracies' goals usually revolve around obtaining private goods, whereas democracies tend to aim for public goods (Graham, et al. 2017). This could make it extremely difficult to have a single shared battle plan. At the same time, democracies and autocracies are incentivized to form more powerful coalitions (Graham, et al. 2017), which could serve as an incentive to partner with each other despite the vastly different behaviors exhibited by the two regime types. Partnering with the opposing regime type could also allow members to specialize in conducting operations that best suit their military or grant them access to other members' strategic territory (Morey 2016). This results in the development of the first hypothesis.

H1: *The larger the variance in regime types among members, the more likely the coalition will opt for a parallel command structure.*

Power Distribution

The power distribution of a coalition may also interact with the regime types of the members. If there is an outlier state that is much more powerful, weaker states may forgo their traditional ways of behaving and cede control of their militaries to the more powerful states to create a more centralized command structure. The more powerful state could also force the smaller states to turn over control of their militaries as a condition of their participation. This results in the development of the second hypothesis.

H2: *Coalitions with unevenly distributed power are likelier to opt for a centralized command structure.*

In coalitions with no power imbalance, regime type similarity will likely play a more prominent role in determining command structure. The state's regime type plays a significant role in determining its behavior, and no state is strong enough to force the state to deviate from its traditional behavior.

H3a: *Coalitions with similar regime types and evenly distributed power are likelier to opt for a joint command structure.*

H3b: *Coalitions with different regime types and evenly distributed power are likelier to opt for a parallel command structure.*

Methods and Data

Variables

The dependent variable in this analysis is the coalition's command structure. I used Morey's (2020) list of coalition wars derived from the population of Correlates of War (COW) interstate wars (Sarkees and Wayman 2014) and their corresponding command structures as determined in Morey (2020). Morey (2020) divided the list of coalition wars into three levels of command: Independent/Parallel, Joint, and Central/Unified, for which I created an ordered variable and coded the corresponding command structure as 1-3, respectively.

I used Polity2 scores (Monty G. Marshall 2020) for the independent variables to measure regime similarity and CINC scores (National Material Capabilities (v6.0)) to measure power distribution. First, I had to disaggregate the coalitions down to the state level. I used the entry for each coalition war in Sarkees and Wayman (2014) to identify the specific coalition member

states. Polity2 and CINC scores are not constant over time and change annually, so for consistency, I used states' Polity2 and CINC scores from the year the war began. Once I had the individual scores for each state and year, I aggregated the data back to the coalition level.

I controlled for size and threat level in all the models I ran. The size variable was a count of the coalition members. For threat level, I identified the opponents of each coalition according to the coalition wars' entry in Sarkees and Wayman (2014). For consistency, I found the opponents' CINC scores from the year the war began, and then created a variable that summed the opponents' CINC scores to capture the threat level faced by the coalition.

To capture the variance in scores across the coalition members, I calculated the variance and standard deviation for the CINC and Polity2 scores within a coalition. I used the standard deviation for both measures in the model, as it better reflected the coalition's internal diversity than variance.

I also calculated the range, range residuals, and range per member (range/size) as additional measures of spread to confirm that my initial finding held across different measures. To measure the outliers for both variables, I calculated the coalitions' maximum deviation from the mean score for Polity2 and CINC scores. I also created an extreme polity2 outlier dummy variable to test whether the mere presence of an ideological outlier has a disruptive effect on the likelihood of adopting a centralized command structure. I created the variable power-weighted polity, which weighted the Polity2 scores of states based on the percentage their CINC score makes up of the total coalition CINC score. This variable tests whether powerful states dominate the decision-making process, and potentially overpower weaker states that are ideological outliers.

$$\text{PowerWeightedPolity} = \frac{\sum_{i=1}^N (\text{Polity2}_i \times \text{CINC}_i)}{\sum_{i=1}^N \text{CINC}_i}$$

Models

I used ordered logistic regression to test these variables because the command structure is an ordinal variable. Each different category represents an increase in the level of centralization within the command structure. For all the models capturing different variables related to Polity2 scores, the standard deviation of coalitions' CINC score was included as a control, and for the variables associated with CINC scores, the standard deviation of coalitions' Polity2 score was included as a control.

Results

Table 1a: *Results for Key Predictor Variables from Polity Models*

Key Predictors from Polity Models

Predictor	Coefficient	P-Value	AIC
Polity2 Standard Deviation (Logit)	-0.492	0.001***	66.46
Polity2 Standard Deviation (Probit)	-0.28	0.001***	67.23
Polity2 Variance	-0.03	0.004***	67.08
Polity2 Range	-0.238	0.001***	67.73
Polity2 Range per Member	-0.857	0.002***	66.83
Polity2 Range Residual	-0.238	0.001***	67.73
Polity2 Range x Size	0.012	0.592	69.45
Maximum Polity2 Deviation	-0.465	0.002***	70.62
Maximum Polity2 Deviation x Size	0.0333	0.3527	71.46
Extreme Outlier Dummy Variable	1.8166	0.1903	70.62
Power-Weighted Polity	-0.042	0.47	80.86

*** $p < 0.01$; ** $p < 0.05$; * $p < 0.10$

Table 1b: *Results for Key Predictor Variables from CINC Models*

Key Predictors from CINC Models

Predictor	Coefficient	P-Value	AIC
CINC Standard Deviation (Logit)	-8.091	0.439	66.46
CINC Standard Deviation (Probit)	-3.042	0.621	67.23
Maximum CINC Deviation	0.477	0.781	66.98
CINC Range	0.161	0.892	67.04
CINC Range per Member	-3.138	0.488	66.57
CINC Range Residuals	0.407	0.909	67.04

*** $p < 0.01$; ** $p < 0.05$; * $p < 0.10$

The results across all models using CINC-based predictors consistently indicate that material power disparity among coalition members does not significantly affect the choice of

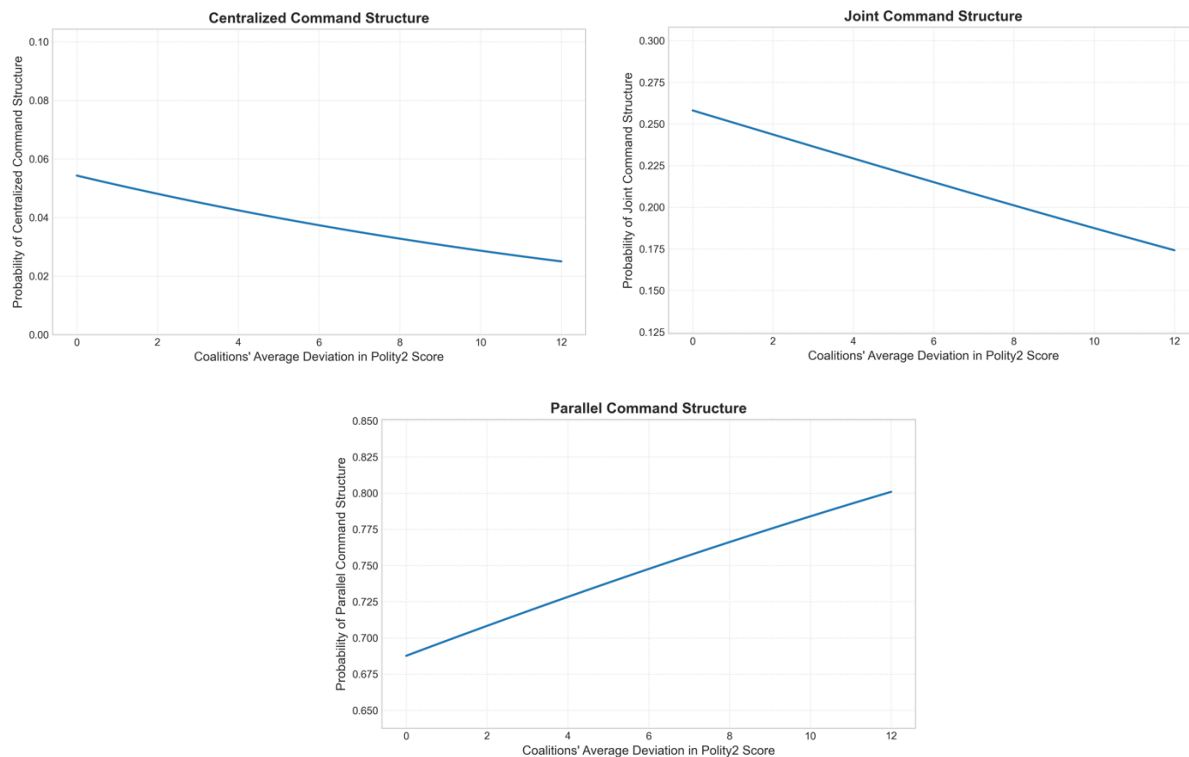
command structure. Whether operationalized as the standard deviation of CINC scores, the maximum deviation from the coalition mean, the range between the most and least powerful members, or more refined metrics like range per member and residual deviation, none of the CINC indicators meet the statistical significance threshold. In both logit and probit specifications, p-values remain well above conventional significance thresholds, and effect directions are inconsistent, underscoring the lack of a systematic pattern. These findings suggest that military and economic capabilities variations among coalition partners do not meaningfully influence whether command structures are centralized or decentralized. The empirical results provide no support for Hypothesis 2, which posited that coalitions with unevenly distributed power would be more likely to adopt centralized command structures. This inconsistency in the direction of the coefficients, coupled with the consistent lack of significance, suggests that, contrary to expectations, power disparity is not a meaningful determinant of command structure decisions within military coalitions.

The logit and probit models of the standard deviation of Polity scores are strong, negative, and statistically significant predictors of less centralized command. Polity variance, range, and range per member are also significant and negative, supporting the conclusion that greater regime heterogeneity among the coalition predicts command structure decentralization. The coefficient for the range residual is negative and statistically significant, indicating that when ideological diversity is greater than expected based on coalition size, the coalition is much less likely to adopt a centralized command. This finding reinforces the broader pattern across the models: ideological fragmentation poses a substantive obstacle to integration, even after controlling for coalition size, material power inequality (CINC standard deviation), and external threat.

The interaction term between Polity2 Range and coalition size, however, is not significant, indicating that the destabilizing effect of regime diversity does not depend on the size of the coalition and constrains both small and large coalitions. The variable measuring the maximum deviation from the coalition's average Polity2 tests whether extreme regime-type outliers within a coalition influence the command structure. It is statistically significant and negatively signed, indicating that coalitions with a highly divergent member, regardless of the average regime type, are significantly less likely to centralize command. The variable Maximum Polity2 Deviation x Size tests whether the effect of ideological extremity within coalitions is

moderated by coalition size. The results show that coalition size does not significantly alter the effect.

Figure 1: *Predicted Probabilities of Different Command Structures by Average Polity Score Deviation from the Mean*



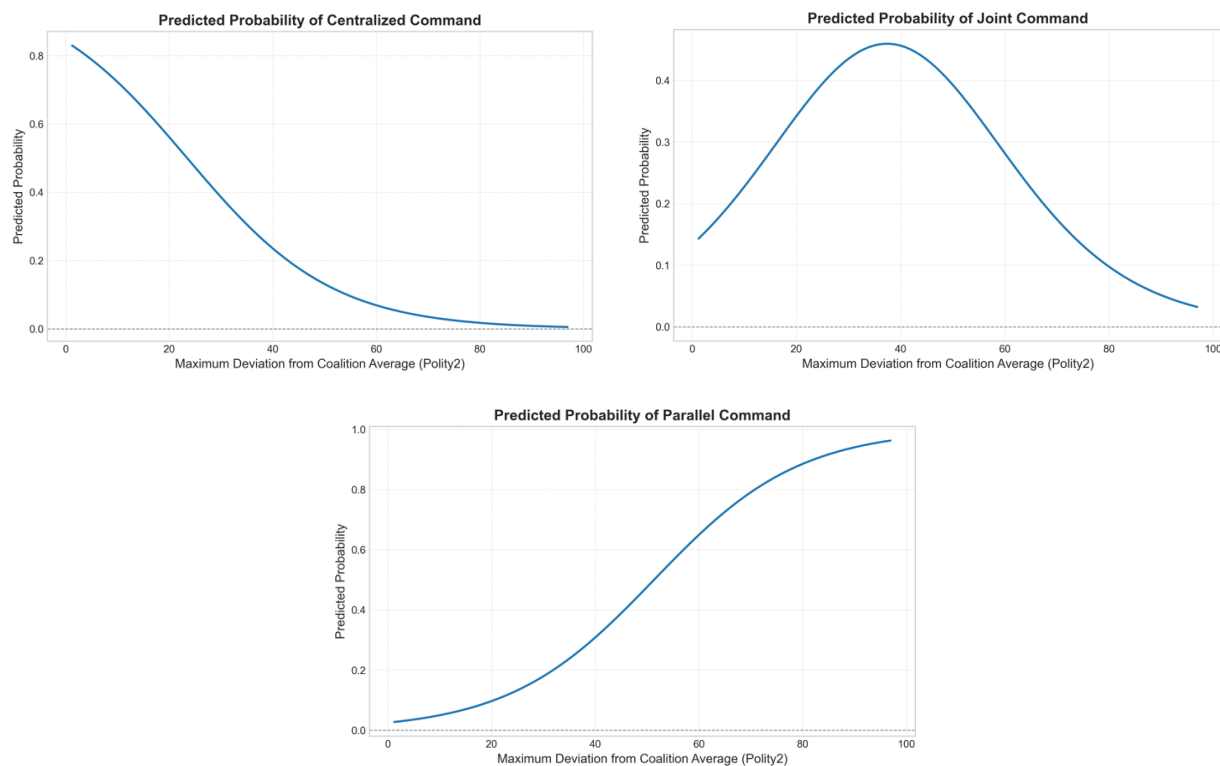
The variable power-weighted polity tests whether the regime type of more powerful coalition members influences the command structure. The results indicate that power-weighted polity is not a statistically significant predictor of command structure. This suggests that powerful members' ideological leadership is insufficient to drive integration. It also suggests that ideological cohesion across the entire coalition, not just among its most powerful members, matters for centralized command structures.

The results offer strong support for Hypothesis 3b and partial support for Hypothesis 3a. Specifically, the models consistently show that coalitions with greater regime-type heterogeneity are significantly less likely to adopt centralized command structures. This pattern aligns with H3b's expectation that coalitions with divergent regime types, but relatively even distributions of power are more likely to select parallel command structures, which require less ideological

cohesion. Hypothesis 3a, which predicts that ideologically cohesive and power-balanced coalitions will opt for joint command structures, receives only partial support. While the data demonstrate that ideological cohesion promotes greater centralization, the models do not isolate whether coalitions move specifically toward joint rather than fully centralized command arrangements. Measures of power symmetry consistently fail to reach statistical significance. As a result, the evidence supports the central role of regime-type similarity in shaping command decisions but does not confirm that even power distribution is a necessary or sufficient condition for joint command adoption.

Across all models, the results provide strong and consistent evidence that ideological heterogeneity among coalition members is a key determinant of command structure, while material power disparity plays no meaningful role. Multiple measures of regime-type diversity are negatively signed and statistically significant, indicating that coalitions with more divergent regime types are significantly less likely to adopt centralized command structures. These effects remain robust across model specifications and are not conditioned by coalition size or mitigated by external threats. By contrast, all indicators of power asymmetry, including CINC standard deviation, range, maximum deviation, and outlier dummies, consistently fail to reach statistical significance. The Power-Weighted Polity2 variable, designed to capture the influence of powerful democracies or autocracies, is likewise insignificant, suggesting that ideological cohesion across the full coalition, not just among dominant states, shapes decisions about command integration. Interaction terms involving size also show no significant effects, reinforcing the conclusion that ideological outliers are disruptive regardless of size. These findings support the hypothesis that ideological compatibility predicts centralized coalition command structures.

Figure 2: *Predicted Probabilities of Different Command Structures by Maximum Polity Score Deviation from the Mean*



Conclusion

The results of this study find that regime-type similarity among coalition members is a critical determinant of command structure, while power distribution does not significantly predict command structure. Across a wide range of model specifications, coalitions with greater ideological cohesion are far more likely to adopt centralized or joint command structures, suggesting that shared political institutions and values facilitate trust, reduce transaction costs, and improve operational coordination. Conversely, ideological fragmentation, especially the presence of extreme regime outliers, consistently predicts a shift toward decentralized or parallel command arrangements. Notably, measures of power distribution have no significant effect, even when interacting with regime-type variables or controlling for coalition size and external threat.

These findings carry several important policy implications for alliance formation and military planning. First, ideological alignment should be treated as a strategic asset in coalition design, not merely a political coincidence. States seeking to build cohesive, integrated military operations should prioritize partners with compatible regime types, as these partners are

demonstrably more likely to support and implement centralized coordination. Second, when ideological diversity is unavoidable, such as in ad hoc coalitions or broad security frameworks, planners should anticipate and accommodate command fragmentation by investing in interoperable communications, flexible command hierarchies, or decentralized decision-making protocols. Finally, the results show that even powerful states cannot override the constraints of ideological incompatibility. Political cohesion, not just military capability, is essential for effective coalition command. This raises strategic considerations for dominant states like the United States or NATO leaders: soft power and political alignment may be as critical as hard power in shaping effective coalition command arrangements. Ultimately, these results underscore that political cohesion can be seen as both a diplomatic virtue and a strategic asset in the effectiveness of military coalitions.

Future Research

Future Research on this topic could explore the effect of the different alliances and treaties among the coalition members, both past and current. It could also examine whether past successful combat experience mitigates the decentralizing effect of regime-type heterogeneity.

Constraints

This paper only used one measure for both power distribution and regime type. Other measures capture those variables that, if I had the time, I would have included in my analysis for robustness. The findings of this paper may not be consistent with those of models that use other measures for the variables. No definitive conclusions about the consistency of the results across measures can be made without further testing. This project also included only the size and threat level as variables across models. If I had the time, I would have included controls for duration and whether the coalition comprised a majority of NATO members. The sample for this project only consisted of about 40 entries, as that is the entire population of Interstate Coalitions Wars in COW. I only had the command structure data for Interstate Coalitions Wars, not MIDs. Given the time, it would be worthwhile to go through and code the command structure data for MIDs to include them in the sample.

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Appendix

Ordered Logit Model (Std Dev Predictors) (Model 1)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.228

AIC: 66.46

BIC: 76.12

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Polity2_Std	-0.4921	0.1507	-3.2661	0.0011	-0.7874	-0.1968
Cinc_Std	-8.0906	10.4622	-0.7733	0.4393	-28.5962	12.415
size	0.36	0.1779	2.0238	0.043	0.0114	0.7085
Threat Level	7.1473	5.7485	1.2433	0.2137	-4.1194	18.4141
1/2	-2.3022	0.9699	-2.3736	0.0176	-4.2031	-0.4012
2/3	0.7238	0.2972	2.4353	0.0149	0.1413	1.3064

Ordered Probit Model (Std Dev Predictors) (Model 2)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.613

AIC: 67.23

BIC: 76.89

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Polity2_Std	-0.28	0.0834	-3.3587	0.0008	-0.4434	-0.1166
Cinc_Std	-3.0422	6.1591	-0.4939	0.6213	-15.1139	9.0294
size	0.2081	0.1021	2.0383	0.0415	0.008	0.4081
Threat Level	3.8297	2.9639	1.2921	0.1963	-1.9795	9.6388

1/2	-1.1598	0.5113	-2.2681	0.0233	-2.162	-0.1576
2/3	0.125	0.278	0.4498	0.6529	-0.4198	0.6699

Ordered Probit Model (Variance Predictors) (Model 3)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.539

AIC: 67.08

BIC: 76.74

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Polity2_Variance	-0.0296	0.0102	-2.9146	0.0036	-0.0496	-0.0097
Cinc_Variance	-49.3264	54.9202	-0.8981	0.3691	-156.968	58.3152
size	0.185	0.1095	1.6904	0.091	-0.0295	0.3996
Threat Level	3.9088	2.8873	1.3538	0.1758	-1.7502	9.5678
1/2	-0.9951	0.5156	-1.9301	0.0536	-2.0055	0.0154
2/3	0.1093	0.276	0.3958	0.6923	-0.4318	0.6503

Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Range) (Model 4)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.863

AIC: 67.73

BIC: 77.39

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Polity2_Range	-0.2382	0.0719	-3.3112	0.0009	-0.3792	-0.0972
Cinc_Std	-7.2865	10.1658	-0.7168	0.4735	-27.2111	12.6382
size	0.4432	0.1891	2.3437	0.0191	0.0726	0.8139
Threat Level	9.2701	6.2733	1.4777	0.1395	-3.0253	21.5656
1/2	-1.8328	0.902	-2.0319	0.0422	-3.6007	-0.0648

2/3	0.7075	0.2995	2.3627	0.0181	0.1206	1.2944
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Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Range per Member) (Model 5)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.417

AIC: 66.83

BIC: 76.50

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Range_per_Member	-0.8574	0.2706	-3.1688	0.0015	-1.3877	-0.3271
Cinc_Std	-8.6278	10.573	-0.816	0.4145	-29.3506	12.095
size	0.0797	0.1335	0.5975	0.5502	-0.1818	0.3413
Threat Level	8.2592	6.0105	1.3741	0.1694	-3.5212	20.0396
1/2	-3.1252	1.0712	-2.9173	0.0035	-5.2248	-1.0256
2/3	0.7338	0.2996	2.4491	0.0143	0.1466	1.3211

Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Range Residuals) (Model 6)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.863

AIC: 67.73

BIC: 77.39

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Range_Residual	-0.2382	0.0719	-3.3112	0.0009	-0.3792	-0.0972
Cinc_Std	-7.2865	10.1658	-0.7168	0.4735	-27.2111	12.6381
size	0.0987	0.1407	0.7016	0.483	-0.1771	0.3745
Threat Level	9.27	6.2733	1.4777	0.1395	-3.0254	21.5654
1/2	-1.5977	0.8897	-1.7959	0.0725	-3.3415	0.146
2/3	0.7075	0.2995	2.3627	0.0181	0.1206	1.2944

Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Range x Size) (Model 7)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.725

AIC: 69.45

BIC: 80.73

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Polity2_Range	-0.2808	0.1107	-2.5371	0.0112	-0.4978	-0.0639
size	0.2565	0.3816	0.6723	0.5014	-0.4913	1.0043
Polity2_Range_x_Size	0.0121	0.0225	0.5362	0.5918	-0.032	0.0562
Cinc_Std	-6.8527	10.2296	-0.6699	0.5029	-26.9023	13.1969
Threat Level	9.7397	6.4628	1.507	0.1318	-2.9272	22.4066
1/2	-2.3699	1.3621	-1.7399	0.0819	-5.0395	0.2997
2/3	0.7277	0.3026	2.4049	0.0162	0.1346	1.3209

Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Outlier Dummy and Maximum Deviation from Mean) (Model 8)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -28.309

AIC: 70.62

BIC: 81.89

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Max_Deviation_from_Mean	-0.4645	0.1465	-3.1707	0.0015	-0.7517	-0.1774
Has_Extreme_Outlier	1.8166	1.3872	1.3096	0.1903	-0.9022	4.5354
size	0.3471	0.1861	1.8654	0.0621	-0.0176	0.7118
Cinc_Std	-5.1792	10.1768	-0.5089	0.6108	-25.1253	14.7669
Threat Level	11.7316	6.8861	1.7036	0.0884	-1.765	25.2282
1/2	-1.9358	0.909	-2.1297	0.0332	-3.7173	-0.1543

2/3	0.7095	0.3024	2.3463	0.019	0.1168	1.3021
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Ordered Logit Model (Polity2 Max. Deviation x Size) (Model 9)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -28.731

AIC: 71.46

BIC: 82.74

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
Max_Deviation_from_Mean	-0.4827	0.1855	-2.6017	0.0093	-0.8464	-0.1191
size	0.1195	0.3422	0.3491	0.727	-0.5513	0.7903
MaxDeviation_x_Size	0.0333	0.0359	0.9293	0.3527	-0.037	0.1037
Cinc_Std	-6.738	9.9327	-0.6784	0.4975	-26.2057	12.7296
Threat Level	11.7564	6.7017	1.7542	0.0794	-1.3787	24.8916
1/2	-2.4732	1.2897	-1.9176	0.0552	-5.001	0.0546
2/3	0.6843	0.3015	2.2694	0.0232	0.0933	1.2752

Ordered Logit Model (Power-Weighted Polity2) (Model 10)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -35.432

AIC: 80.86

BIC: 88.92

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
PowerWeightedPolity	-0.0416	0.0576	-0.7226	0.4699	-0.1546	0.0713
size	0.092	0.1411	0.6517	0.5146	-0.1846	0.3685
Threat Level	5.2012	4.2361	1.2278	0.2195	-3.1014	13.5038
1/2	-0.7635	0.7088	-1.0771	0.2814	-2.1528	0.6258
2/3	0.3226	0.2888	1.1168	0.2641	-0.2435	0.8886

Ordered Logit Model (CINC Outlier Dummy) (Model 11)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.508

AIC: 67.02

BIC: 76.68

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
CINC_Extreme_Outlier	0.2109	1.0643	0.1982	0.8429	-1.8751	2.2969
size	0.3357	0.2014	1.6669	0.0955	-0.059	0.7304
Polity2_Std	-0.5037	0.1552	-3.2461	0.0012	-0.8078	-0.1996
Threat Level	4.9997	4.8945	1.0215	0.307	-4.5933	14.5927
1/2	-2.0219	0.8876	-2.2781	0.0227	-3.7615	-0.2824
2/3	0.6996	0.2953	2.3693	0.0178	0.1209	1.2784

Ordered Logit Model (CINC Maximum Deviation from Mean) (Model 12)

Dependent Variable: Command

Link Function: Probit

Log-Likelihood: -27.508

AIC: 67.02

BIC: 76.68

Number of Observations: 37

Variable	Coef.	Std. Err.	z	P> z	[0.025	0.975]
CINC_Extreme_Outlier	0.2109	1.0643	0.1982	0.8429	-1.8751	2.2969
size	0.3357	0.2014	1.6669	0.0955	-0.059	0.7304
Polity2_Std	-0.5037	0.1552	-3.2461	0.0012	-0.8078	-0.1996
Threat Level	4.9997	4.8945	1.0215	0.307	-4.5933	14.5927
1/2	-2.0219	0.8876	-2.2781	0.0227	-3.7615	-0.2824
2/3	0.6996	0.2953	2.3693	0.0178	0.1209	1.2784